… the Muslim majority. Realpolitik could instead have dictated moving in a completely different direction" (*ibid.*, 334). In parallel fashion, Crossley (2019: 87–88) explored the array of religio-cultural choices and their consequences among the Bulgars. For the Khazars and Judaism, cf. Amitai 2008: 283–284 and notes; Kaplony 2008: 320–321; and esp. Golden (2013: 53–56), who noted that, parallel to the Shansabanis' "origin myth," the Judaicization of the Khazar ruling elites – encompassing both the *qaghan* or sacral king, and the subordinate governing king (Ar. *malik*) – had also begun during the reign of Harun al-Rashid.

79. See esp. Bosworth 1994: 67–69, 79–80; Siddiqui 2006: 19–20.
80. Bosworth 1961: 128–129.
81. See also Gardizi (trans. Bosworth) 2011: 57; Bosworth 2008: 100; Bosworth 2012c. For the Karramiyya in Nishapur and Ghur, cf. Bulliet 1972: 12–13, 68ff., 71ff.; Zysow 2012; and Chapter 4. Regarding the Karramiyya's proselytism in particular, Amitai (2008: 283–284) noted that, while they were "the best organized group of Sufi character … [with] *khanqah*s in Farghana, Khuttal and Samarqand," they actually were *not* very successful agents of Islamic conversion among the Turkic peoples of Transoxiana during the tenth–eleventh centuries. Much needed re-examination of the long-held notion of Sufis as the major force in the Steppe Turks' Islamization has led scholars to propose instead that traveling Muslim merchants, a few select political–military figures, and even mainstream but itinerant *fuqaha'* were the more likely purveyors of exposure – with only *eventual* conversion – to Islam among the Turkic peoples. See Flood 2005a: 272 and *passim*; cf. also Chapter 4.
82. See esp. Barth 1961: 135–136; Barfield 1981: 76–77; Amiri 2020: 151–152. Gellner (1983: 446) additionally advocated for "… a tribal Little Culture, which does not meet the standards of an old Great Tradition, [and] should not be denied for the past simply because it no longer satisfies the needs of a more urbanized, centralized, literate society which has replaced it."
83. During the first and second millennia CE in West through Central Asia (and beyond), identifiable religious communities – such as Manicheists, Buddhists, Nestorian Christians, and Muslims – had constituted major mercantile forces within larger polities. Their commercial power lay largely in the ability to partner with co-religionists, kinsmen, and others to create and utilize vast transregional networks for the circulation of goods and capital. The "corporate" integration of these mercantile networks made religious conversion advantageous, as in the case of the Uighur conversions to Manicheism, and the Bulgar conversions to Islam (see Jackson 2017: 333–334). It was perhaps due to the absence of such identifiable modes of "incorporation" (i.e., conversion) into "Hinduism" that the networks of Gujarati, Panjabi, and Marwari merchants in Central Asia did not achieve the prominence and longevity of other groups. Cf. esp. Dale 1994; Levi 2002.
84. While the presence of Jewish communities throughout Afghanistan – attested at Bamiyan and Ghazna (cf., e.g., Haim 2012; Haim 2019) and elsewhere – Jam-Firuzkuh's tenuous geographic connectivity and "the dearth of clearly stratified occupation" led D. Thomas (pers. comm., October 2018) to raise the